

Takeaways

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- The **central issue** is whether active forest management is ecologically legitimate under novel climate conditions. We believe that ecological forest management following the guidelines outlined in GTR-220, coupled with prescribed fire maintenance, will create more resilient forests and reduce fire risk (North *et al.*, 2009).
- Biomass utilization is **integrate process** of forest health treatments.
- Continued business as usual will mean that California's forests continue being a **net emitter of carbon**. Biomass utilization is not free of greenhouse gas emissions; however, it is part of a solution to greatly reduce massive emissions from uncontrolled wildfires.
- The **economics of biomass utilization** are not about subsidizing energy production. They are about reducing catastrophic losses, stabilizing long-term risk, and capturing value from material streams that already exist as a consequence of forest restoration.
- Policies that **focus on reducing emissions** from biomass while **integrating forest health solutions** with climate change are critical to the long-term biodiversity and human health throughout California and the West.

Background

In December 2025, Shaye Wolf published a [commentary](#) claiming that biomass is a money pit that will not solve California's energy or wildfire problems. The piece cited research by authors whose work has been widely challenged by climate and forest scientists, and it made several claims that were either unsupported or inaccurate. Shortly afterward, Matt Dias of the California Forestry Association responded, arguing that biomass utilization is not primarily about renewable energy production, but about confronting the wildfire crisis created by a century of fire suppression.

We believe the debate cannot be understood through a narrow energy lens alone. A durable response to California's forest and fire crises requires restoring forest conditions that can function under current and future climate realities. That includes re-establishing fire regimes that, as Kat Anderson has described, "tend the wild," combining active intervention with restraint. In the short and medium term, this will require ecologically informed removal of excess trees and underbrush, along with responsible management of the byproducts generated by those treatments. The goal is not extraction, but restoring balance and ecological function through cultural burning, intentional fire, and selective, place-based forestry practices.

All living species interact with their environments in order to survive; humans are no different. People have actively engaged with California's forests using fire since these ecosystems emerged at the end of the last ice age. The question, then, is not whether humans can or should be involved in living systems, but whether that involvement is wise, adaptive, proportional, or destructive. Indigenous stewardship offers an essential reference point here, grounded in practices that combine active intervention with clear guidance on when, where, and how to apply fire, and when to step back. It is the breakdown of those relationships, not human presence itself, that lies at the root of today's forest and wildfire crisis.

This article examines the need for forest health treatments that produce biomass and addresses common myths surrounding its utilization. It then situates the biomass debate within broader patterns of wildfire disinformation, explores impacts on biodiversity, and outlines integrated solutions for restoring forest resilience.

Biomass

Debates over biomass are often framed narrowly, as disputes over energy technology or emissions accounting. In practice, many critiques of biomass draw on broader misunderstandings about wildfire, forest structure, and the role of human intervention in fire-adapted landscapes. Claims such as "fires are mostly a shrubland problem," "thinning increases fire severity," or "forests should be left alone" shape public perception long before questions of biomass utilization are considered.

When these assumptions go unexamined, biomass becomes a proxy target for deeper anxieties about forest management. The result is a familiar pattern: misunderstood fire ecology leads to misdiagnosed forest conditions, which in turn produce a misframed biomass debate and, ultimately, policies that fail to reduce wildfire risk. This

sequence does little to address the underlying drivers of large, high-severity fires in the western United States and obscures the material realities created by necessary forest restoration.

THE disagreement

In reality, the debate isn't really about biomass. It's about whether active forest management is ecologically legitimate under novel climate conditions. CBD's position implicitly says restraint and retreat are the answer; yours says intervention, done carefully, is unavoidable. Surfacing that philosophical split would make the argument clearer and more honest.

Forest residuals

Biomass utilization is a critical downstream process of forest health treatments. It is not a driver of logging. In mitigating wildfire, we need to make the distinction between 1. sawtimber, 2. unavoidable treatment residues, and 3. Excess forest biomass or residual streams exist whether or not there's an energy market. We also need to make it clear that sawtimber, clearcutting, or excessive forest harvesting cannot be conflated with forest health or wildfire mitigation.

Burning & air quality

Let's acknowledge that older biomass plants were dirty, but modern regulations, controls, and siting are helping to mitigate that issue. These and environmental justice impacts from siting facilities in disadvantaged communities can be further strengthened with strong CEQA and other environmental policies. Nevertheless, poor air quality and greenhouse gas emissions from wildfires dwarf regulated point sources. The nearly million-acre Dixie fire, California's second-largest wildfire, emitted 37 million tonnes of CO_{2e} or the equivalent emissions from electricity consumption of nearly 5 million households (Baldassare, 2024). In 2020, wildfires emitted 127 million tons of CO_{2e}, nearly twice California's total greenhouse gas emissions reductions achieved since 2003 (Jerrett *et al.*, 2022).

Wolf suggests leaving biomass residues in the forest. Masticating on site, lopping and pilling, or removing residue to landings has long been practiced at thinning sites. But the accumulation of materials is overwhelming. A study showed that there are approximately 150,000 acres of piles representing 1,000,000 tons, with 78% of these materials on public lands (Darlington *et al.*, 2023).¹ Even disposing of those piles by burning is an episodic, unregulated process that would be much more harmful than utilization in long-term wood products or burning at a facility.

Energy vs. material flow

We need to separate "biomass as energy" from "biomass as material-flow management." Wolf collapses everything into burning trees for electricity. Biomass utilization is neither an energy silver bullet nor an unending consumer of timber and spewer of wood smoke from giant burning plants. Rather, it is one of several tools for addressing California's wildfire crisis, which itself is the result of a century of fire suppression that has produced unnaturally dense, stressed forests increasingly vulnerable to disease, drought, and high-severity fire under a warming climate.

The broader challenge is not energy production per se, but system efficiency: how to handle unavoidable forest residues once they are generated by necessary forest health treatments. From that perspective, biomass utilization is best understood as part of a landscape-scale risk-reduction and materials-management strategy, spanning multiple uses including long-lived wood products, combined heat and power, thermal energy, and biochar.

One useful way to think about this is as a full-circle wood economy (Figure 1), in which forest biomass flows into three broad pathways: burn, bury, or build. Burn includes both open-pile burning and energy generation; bury includes decomposition, landfilling, or unmanaged decay; and build includes integrating wood-based carbon into

¹Only 19% of this material is accessible via existing road networks.

longer-lived material uses, such as mass timber, engineered wood products, biochar, and soil amendments that store carbon for decades or even centuries while displacing more emissions-intensive materials.



Figure 1: Products from ecologically managed forests. Burn (red upper left) = in fire-prone forests, using wood to power low-emission bioenergy facilities replaces fossil fuels and produces less GHGs than pile burning or mega fires. Bury (green lower left) = compost is one of the simplest products made from any woody biomass, requiring little energy and diverting biomass from landfills (where it can generate methane, a greenhouse gas). Build (brown/green lower right) = making productive use of harvested wood is difficult due to a lack of processing infrastructure. More distributed solutions for utilizing small-diameter wood for building material should be pursued to create a viable economy for ecological forest management.

Seen this way, the policy question is not whether biomass exists; it does. The question is whether we design systems that treat it as a resource whose fate can be shaped deliberately. The system question could reflect nature, e.g., maximizing the system efficiency by finding uses for every element in the residue equation. This includes both utilization and leaving in place.

Economics

At the statewide scale, cost–benefit analyses illustrate both the magnitude of the problem and the opportunity. As shown in Figure 2, reaching California’s current goal of treating one million acres per year requires substantial investment, but the estimated benefits already exceed costs by a wide margin (Brown, 2024). At treatment levels closer to what is required to meaningfully reduce wildfire risk after a century of fire suppression, net benefits increase further. Whereas these dollar values may appear large, they reflect the true scale of avoided suppression costs, reduced disaster losses, and long-term risk stabilization in a state where wildfire has become one of the most expensive unmanaged liabilities.

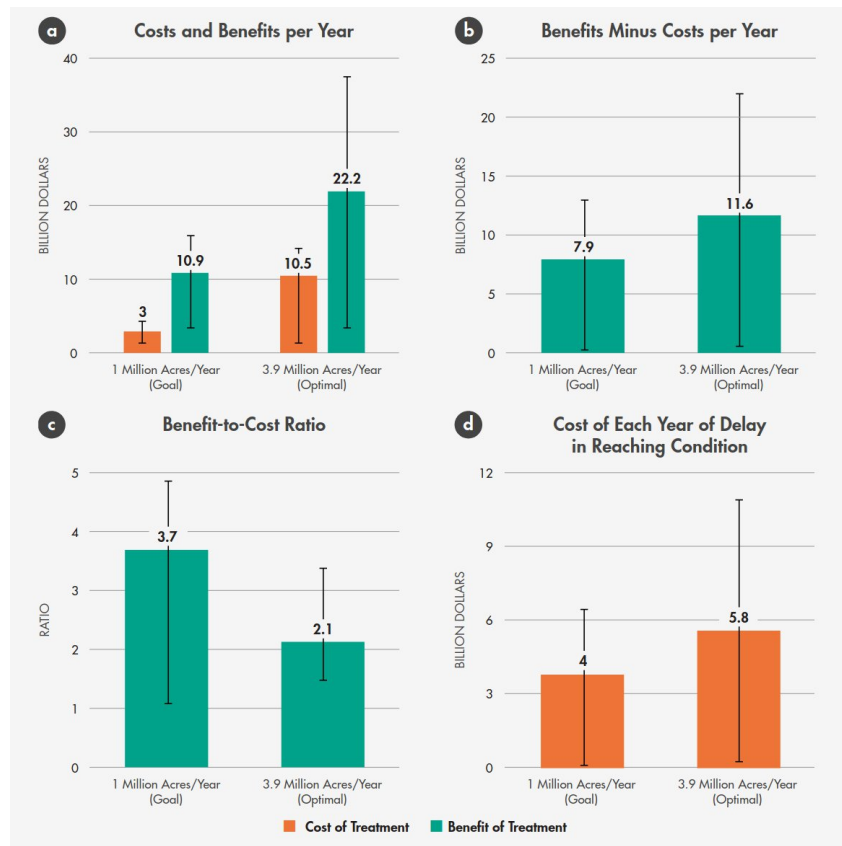


Figure 2: Costs/benefits of California fuel reduction at the goal of 1 million acres vs. 3.9 million acres—the rate that maximizes net benefits (Brown, 2024).

Additional studies reinforce this conclusion; estimating returns on investment of more than three dollars for every dollar spent on fuel treatments and benefit–cost ratios approaching four when avoided damages are included (Strabo *et al.*, 2025; Turner, 2023). The economic question, then, is no longer whether California can afford to treat its forests, but whether it can afford not to.

Large-scale forest treatments inevitably generate substantial volumes of woody material. From an economic standpoint, this material is not optional; it is an unavoidable byproduct of necessary restoration. If it is left in place, piled, or masticated, wildfire risk is often shifted rather than reduced, and carbon is released through decay or open burning without benefit. That biomass must go somewhere. Deliberate utilization converts an unavoidable cost into a managed material flow that supports risk reduction rather than undermining it.

Another longer-term economic value is often undercounted: carbon storage and avoided emissions. Using forest biomass in longer-lived products such as mass timber, engineered wood, or biochar effectively sequesters carbon that would otherwise be released through wildfire or decomposition, while simultaneously displacing more emissions-intensive materials. Modeling studies show that treated forest scenarios can result in greater total carbon storage over time despite substantially lower tree densities, due to reduced wildfire emissions and increased growth of large trees (Elias *et al.*, 2025; Delyser *et al.*, 2025).

Taken together, the economics of biomass utilization are not about subsidizing energy production. They are about reducing catastrophic losses, stabilizing long-term risk, and capturing value from material streams that result from forest restoration. In this context, biomass utilization functions less as a cost center and more as preventive infrastructure—an investment that lowers future public expenditures while supporting more resilient forests, communities, and regional economies.

BIOMASS FAQs

In addition to wildfire and climate disinformation, several recurring claims about biomass utilization appear frequently in public debate. These arguments often rely on incomplete framing, and their resolutions benefit from clarification and nuance.

1. **Biomass is not a downstream process.** A common claim is that thinned biomass should simply be left in the forest rather than removed or utilized. In practice, leaving large volumes of treated material in place can suppress understory regeneration and, in some cases, increase fire risk. In extreme scenarios, residual piles or log decks have contributed to fire spread. The 2021 Dixie Fire, which burned more than one million acres across the Plumas National Forest, is widely acknowledged to have spread in part through a log deck and thinned fuel piles left on site after forest operations. At the scale now required for restoration, residual material must be actively managed rather than assumed to be benign.
2. **Carbon accounting is context dependent.** Biomass utilization is not zero carbon, even with modern technologies that reduce emissions. However, in fire-prone forests, the relevant comparison is not biomass versus no emissions, but biomass versus uncontrolled wildfire and decay. Large wildfires release immense amounts of carbon rapidly and unpredictably, often exposing downwind communities to smoke for weeks or months. Due to repeated high-severity fires, California's forests have been a net source of carbon emissions since 2015 (Delyser *et al.*, 2025). Leaving biomass from thinning projects in place does not eliminate emissions and can shift wildfire risk or create unnatural conditions from excessive wood chips on the forest floor. Carbon accounting must also include sequestration. In treated forests, large trees grow larger, and total carbon storage can increase over time. A recent simulation found that treated forest scenarios retained 6% more carbon despite a 74% reduction in trees per acre (Elias *et al.*, 2025).
3. **Concerns about “feeding the beast” are geographic.** Opponents of biomass utilization often raise concerns about creating demand that incentivizes harvesting from intact or old-growth forests, citing examples from the southeastern United States or Europe (Frisch & Uden, 2022). Those concerns deserve scrutiny, but they do not translate directly to the American West. In California and much of the western United States, biomass associated with utilization proposals overwhelmingly comes from wildfire mitigation and forest health treatments. Approximately ninety percent of forest land is publicly owned or held by small private landowners, and large-scale industrial clearcutting for biomass is neither the dominant practice nor the policy goal.
4. **Biomass is not an energy silver bullet.** Biomass energy is not intended to replace renewable energy sources such as solar or wind. Its role is local and complementary, focused on managing unavoidable material streams produced by forest restoration. Compared with open pile burning or uncontrolled wildfire, regulated utilization can be less polluting and more predictable. The central issue is not biomass versus other renewables, but how California addresses its wildfire emergency while managing the material consequences of necessary forest treatments (Dias, 2025).
5. **Policy incentives shape outcomes, not extraction.** Programs such as the Bioenergy Market Adjusting Tariff Program, or BIOMAT, required utilities to purchase power from small, local facilities that convert forest biomass to energy. The program was designed to support material processing capacity near treatment areas, not to drive increased harvesting. With the program's expiration, facilities capable of handling biomass from forest health projects have idled or closed. Creating a successor program that enables appropriately sited facilities to operate, or re-idle facilities such as Loyalton, is critical to ensuring that biomass generated through restoration can be processed responsibly rather than disposed of through open burning or left to accumulate on the landscape.

Wildfire disinformation

As with climate change, misinformation about wildfire, forests, and logging has increasingly shaped public understanding and policy debates (Jones *et al.*, 2022). In California, this misinformation is often reinforced by deeply ingrained visual and cultural assumptions about what a healthy forest looks like. Many people implicitly picture dense, closed-canopy forests modeled on the eastern United States, northern Europe, or England, landscapes that evolved under very different climatic and ecological conditions.

California's forests exist largely within a Mediterranean climate, characterized by wet winters and long, hot, dry summers. These conditions favor fire-adapted ecosystems rather than the dense, moisture-rich forests common in temperate eastern regions. When forest health is judged using the wrong ecological reference point, fire-adapted landscapes can be misdiagnosed as degraded or overmanaged, while overly dense stands are mistakenly viewed as natural or desirable.

These misconceptions shape how wildfire risk is interpreted and how solutions are evaluated. Simplified narratives, such as the claim that destructive fires are primarily a shrubland phenomenon, further obscure the reality that California's most damaging fires occur across mixed landscapes that include forests, shrublands, and the wildland–urban interface. When wildfire ecology is misunderstood in this way, forest management and biomass utilization are often framed as unnecessary or harmful rather than as responses to a misaligned, historically altered system.

Wildfire disinformation matters not only because it is inaccurate and undermines accepted science, but because it drives policy choices that fail to address the underlying causes of high-severity fire in a fire-adapted landscape (Cook, 2020).

Fire-adapted forests & cultural fire

A growing body of ecological research, supported by historical records and Indigenous knowledge, makes clear that most of California's landscapes burned regularly prior to Euro-American settlement. From the coast to the Sierra Nevada and beyond, fire occurred on highly variable but frequent cycles, often on the order of five to fifteen years, depending on vegetation type, elevation, and local climate. Fire was not an anomaly in these systems; it was essential to their function.

Indigenous peoples actively shaped these fire regimes through intentional burning, now commonly referred to as cultural burning. These practices did not simply mimic lightning ignitions but actively guided fire to support food systems, medicinal plants, wildlife habitat, travel corridors, and sacred landscapes. Cultural burning worked in concert with natural fire to sustain open, patchy forests, interspersed meadows, and diverse age structures, supporting high levels of biodiversity and resilience.

Decades of fire science align closely with this knowledge. Prior to widespread fire suppression, western forests tended to have larger trees, lower overall density, and greater structural heterogeneity (North *et al.*, 2009; Stephens *et al.*, 2007). The removal of frequent, low- to moderate-severity fire disrupted these systems, allowing fuels to accumulate and forest structure to shift far beyond historical and ecological norms.

Fire suppression

The transition from frequent, smaller fires to the large, high-severity wildfires of today is not a natural evolution but the result of more than a century of fire suppression (Collins *et al.*, 2017; Peery *et al.*, 2019). Historically, regular fire functioned as an active form of landscape management. It improved tree health by reducing competition, clearing understory fuels, removing dead or weakened vegetation, and opening the forest canopy to sunlight. These processes reduced water stress, improved nutrient cycling, and supported the development of meadows and open patches that acted as natural fire breaks.

Frequent fire also interacted with hydrology. By reducing excessive tree density, fire helped balance water demand with available moisture, supporting smaller, localized water cycles and maintaining soil and vegetation health. In these landscapes, most fires burned at lower intensity and often self-extinguished as they encountered patchy fuels and open areas. Large, stand-replacing fires were relatively rare.

Fire suppression reversed these dynamics. Forests became denser and more uniform, fuels accumulated continuously across large areas, and the patchiness that once limited fire spread was lost. Under modern climate conditions, this produced fires that burn hotter, spread farther, and cause far greater ecological and social damage than the frequent fires they replaced.

Restoring fire-adapted landscapes, therefore, requires reintroducing fire as a management tool, alongside thinning and other treatments that help re-establish appropriate structure. In the near term, this process generates large volumes of forest residuals. Biomass utilization does not drive this work; rather, it emerges from it as a practical necessity. Over time, as landscapes regain balance and fire resumes its ecological role, the need for intensive intervention and large-scale biomass handling can and should decline.

Biodiversity

It is well known that indigenous burning, as part of historic fire regimes, enhanced biodiversity (Hoffman *et al.*, 2021). Additional evidence indicates that a combination of thinning and prescribed fire significantly increases

plant diversity in mixed or dry conifer forests (Dodson *et al.*, 2008). However, California is very diverse, and what works in one ecosystem may not work in others, especially in chaparral or mesic systems, where burn frequency is generally too high and thinning or prescribed fire are not applicable treatments. However, in fire-adapted systems, biodiversity is inextricably linked to pyrodiversity (Fernando & McCarthy, 2025).



Solutions

Moving forward, several integrated pathways can support the transition from biomass as an energy ideology to a practical response to an unavoidable byproduct of critical forest restoration efforts:

1. **Climate adaptation and biomass integration.** Rapid scaling of forest health treatments, including thinning and prescribed fire, is critical to maintaining forest resilience in a warming climate (Delyser *et al.*, 2025). Policies that align forest treatments, biomass utilization, climate goals, and greenhouse gas reduction can reduce wildfire risk while ensuring that utilization infrastructure supports, rather than distorts, restoration outcomes.
2. **Mobile & modular processing technologies.** Biomass infrastructure should be flexible and place-based, reflecting the temporary nature of excess fuels created by past fire suppression. Avoiding permanent, oversized facilities reduces the risk of creating demand disconnected from ecological need. Modular and mobile systems can prioritize local utilization, reduce transport emissions, and adapt over time as landscapes recover.
3. **Proactive disaster insurance and risk pricing.** Repeated large-scale wildfires threaten to make entire regions uninsurable and, eventually, uninhabitable. Aligning insurance markets with forest treatment incentives can reduce losses, stabilize premiums, and lower long-term public costs (Harrison, 2025). Disaster response should not form the basis of a growth economy. Instead, policy and market mechanisms can reward risk reduction and penalize continued inaction.
4. **Jobs in the woods and community resilience.** Forest restoration and biomass utilization can create meaningful, long-term employment in rural and fire-prone communities that have experienced decades of economic decline and capacity loss. Investing in local stewardship workforces supports both ecological restoration and social resilience, while helping to reverse patterns of outmigration and disinvestment.
5. **Biodiversity as a guiding constraint.** Biodiversity is not an argument for or against biomass utilization, but it must remain a central constraint on how forest health treatments are designed and implemented. Ecological forestry that creates gaps, clumps, and heterogeneity supports habitat diversity, while indiscriminate thinning or the removal of all snags can undermine ecological goals. Restoration strategies must remain ecosystem-specific and adaptive, recognizing that approaches suitable for dry conifer forests may not apply in chaparral or mesic systems.

Conclusion

Taken together, these pathways point toward a future in which California's forests are once again shaped by frequent, beneficial fire rather than catastrophic megafires. Biomass utilization plays a supporting role in this transition, helping to manage the legacy of fire suppression while landscapes are brought back into balance. The long-term goal is not perpetual intervention, but the restoration of living systems capable of sustaining themselves through wise, adaptive stewardship.

California's wildfire crisis is not the result of too much intervention, but of too little, applied too late, across landscapes that evolved to burn regularly. A century of fire suppression has pushed forests far beyond their ecological carrying capacity, producing dense, fuel-loaded systems that are increasingly vulnerable to drought, disease, and high-severity fire. Addressing this reality requires moving beyond narrow debates about individual tools and toward a whole-systems approach grounded in fire ecology, climate adaptation, and long-term stewardship.

The choice facing California is not between profit and responsibility, but between managed transition and unmanaged failure (Harrison, 2025). Restoring fire-adapted forests means reintroducing frequent, low-intensity fire and rebuilding structural diversity at scale. In the near term, this inevitably requires thinning and other treatments that reduce competition, improve tree health, and lower fire severity. These actions, when followed by prescribed fire, have been shown to reduce wildfire risk, limit stand-replacing fire, and increase forest resilience under extreme conditions, as demonstrated in recent fires such as the Caldor Fire, where prior prescribed burning helped deflect fire behavior and protect surrounding landscapes (North *et al.*, 2022).

Crucially, this restoration work produces large volumes of forest residuals. Biomass utilization does not justify forest intervention, nor does it replace the long-term role of fire. It functions as a transitional tool that helps manage the material consequences of restoring fire-adapted systems while forests move back toward conditions where cultural burning and good fire can once again do most of the work.

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